

Autonomous landing solution of low-cost quadrotor on a moving platform

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HIGHLIGHTS

- A novel landing pad composed of patterns of different sizes is presented.
- The detection method for a low-cost quadrotor is considered.
- A backstepping approach is presented to attenuate the influence of the external disturbance.

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ABSTRACT

In this paper, a complete solution for autonomous landing of a low-cost quadrotor on a moving platform is presented. First, the dynamic model of the quadrotor is described and simplified for landing task. Second, a novel landing pad associated with detection algorithm is designed for robust detection by a low-cost monocular camera. In order to deal with mirror effect and occasional misidentification, a 3D point cluster algorithm for relative position estimation is proposed. Third, using the backstepping approach, an adaptive position controller is designed to calculate the desired attitude for attitude loop. The overall stability of the position loop is proven by a Lyapunov method. Meanwhile, some landing strategies are presented to achieve a safe and stable landing task. Finally, the low-cost system architecture of the quadrotor and the experiment results are both demonstrated to showcase the effectiveness of the proposed method.

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1. Introduction

Nowadays, UAVs receive great attentions from worldwide researchers and commercial companies. UAVs, especially quadrotors which can vertical take off and land (VTOL), are an ideal flight platform for many indoor and outdoor applications including but not limited to aerial surveillance, agricultural irrigation, pipeline inspection and object transporting [1–4]. As an important part of a flight task, autonomous landing is a fundamental yet challenging problem of quadrotors. During a flight task, it is the last but still critical step for the entire flight task.

Due to the importance of the autonomous landing task, several research communities have studied the problem in the past few decades. Representative works are as follows: The authors in [5] presented a real-time computer vision system for a rotor-craft UAV to land onto a known landing target which simplifies the vision computation process. [6] presented an onboard monocular vision system for autonomous landing on a typical landing pad

which consists of the letter 'H' surrounded by a circle. 6 DOF pose of the quadrotor relative to the landing pad can be determined from images using projective geometry. [7] presented a nonlinear controller for a UAV using the measurement of average optical flow on a spherical camera along with the inertial measurement unit (IMU) data to land on a moving platform. In [8], an image-based visual servo controller for the landing problem of a VTOL vehicle was presented. The image of the centroid for a collection of landmarks is used as position measurement and translational optical flow is used as velocity measurement for the autonomous landing. The authors in [9] designed a novel landing pad for the situation that parts of the target are not visible and a vision based detection algorithm for estimation of the 3D position of the UAV relative to the landing pad. [10] presented an integrated control demonstration in which a rotary wing UAV landed on a moving platform using vision-based localization of the target vehicle.

To-date, many vision-based algorithms are developed for autonomous landing of UAVs. Published works investigated the landing on static, moving as well as unknown sites. These algorithms usually require pre-known marker to be attached on the landing sites. In [11], the detection of the marker is based on the color detection algorithm with morphological filter. In [12], a pad

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design aiming for possible detection from high as well as small altitudes was presented. The pattern comprised one red square and one blue circle, which can increase the robustness and range of detection. [6] presented a landing pad which consists of the letter 'H' inside a black circle. The 5 DOF pose was calculated from the elliptic projection of the circle. The remaining geometric ambiguity was resolved after incorporating the estimation of the gravity vector using the vehicle's inertial measurement unit. Respectively, Yang presented an algorithm which did not need a pre-known marker, the landing site was defined by a template image and identified using the matching of detected ORB features. The relative pose was estimated by matching the landing site features to the PTAM map points. But it consequently loses its accuracy in the case of the absence of the map [11].

Most of the papers above adopted global shutter camera as the landing detection sensor [6,8,11], which is even more expensive than the total cost of a quadrotor UAV. Using a low-cost camera will lead to rolling shutter effect [13] and imaging noise because of the rolling shutter and low resolution. In the marker detection, it will decrease the detection accuracy and recall rate. In addition, it will cause mirror effect [14] when we use iterative PnP methods to calculate the relative pose between the camera and marker. However, autonomous landing is a general requirement for quadrotor including low-cost quadrotor. In real applications, there are significant needs to decrease the cost and enhance the practicability of the algorithm.

Aiming at the actual application and low-cost autonomous system, this paper presents a quadrotor system capable of landing on a moving platform using the low-cost onboard vision system. A low-cost monocular camera is employed to detect the landing pad. To solve the negative influence caused by the low-cost camera, vision algorithm and position control law are improved to enhance the landing task robustness and stability. Moreover, some landing strategies are presented to decrease the negative influence caused by low-cost system. The contributions of this paper can be summarized as follows:

- (i) A novel landing pad composed of patterns of different sizes is presented, which can be detected from high as well as very low altitudes. A 3D point cluster algorithm is presented to eliminate wrong estimated poses caused by occasional misidentification and mirror effect of planar landing pad.
- (ii) Backstepping approach is adopted to design an adaptive position controller which can not only track the reference state but also attenuate the influence of the external disturbance.
- (iii) A low-cost and open-source based system architecture is proposed.

The rest of this paper is organized as follows. Section 2 presents the fundamental equations of the dynamic model considered in this work. In Section 3, the landing pad design and the detection algorithm are given. Section 4 presents a position control law and the proof of the controller. Section 5 presents some landing strategies. Experiments setup and practical experiments results are given in Section 7. Finally, Section 8 concludes this paper.

2. Dynamic model

Consider a quadrotor vehicle represented by a rigid body of mass m and of moment of inertia J , as shown in Fig. 1. To describe the motion of the quadrotor, two reference frame are introduced: an world inertial reference $\sum_w$ and a body-fixed frame $\sum_b$ attached to the quadrotor at the mass center. $\mathbf{p} = [x, y, z]^T$ and $\mathbf{v} = [\dot{x}, \dot{y}, \dot{z}]^T$ are, respectively, the position and linear velocity

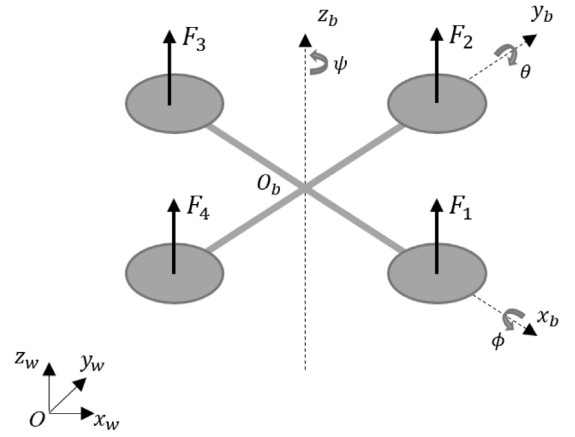


Fig. 1. The quadrotor with corresponding frames.

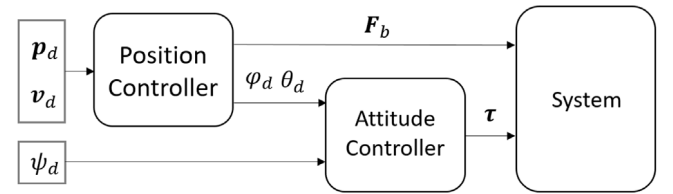


Fig. 2. Hierarchical control scheme of quadrotor.

of the quadrotor in $\sum_w$. With the roll/pitch/yaw angles of the quadrotor represented by $\boldsymbol{\phi} = [\varphi, \theta, \psi]^T$, the rotation matrix R_b from $\sum_b$ to $\sum_w$ is given as

$$R_b = \begin{bmatrix} c_\varphi c_\psi - s_\varphi s_\theta s_\psi & -c_\varphi s_\psi & s_\varphi c_\psi + s_\varphi c_\theta s_\psi \\ c_\theta s_\psi + s_\varphi s_\theta c_\psi & c_\varphi c_\psi & s_\theta s_\psi - s_\varphi c_\theta c_\psi \\ -c_\varphi s_\theta & s_\varphi & c_\varphi c_\theta \end{bmatrix}, \quad (1)$$

where c_γ and s_γ denote, respectively, $\cos \gamma$ and $\sin \gamma$.

In the frame system as shown in Fig. 1. The equations of motion for the quadrotor can be written as:

$$\dot{\mathbf{p}} = \mathbf{v}, \quad (2)$$

$$m\dot{\mathbf{v}} = R_b \mathbf{F}_b - mg\mathbf{e}_3 + \boldsymbol{\Delta}_t, \quad (3)$$

$$J\dot{\boldsymbol{\omega}} = -\boldsymbol{\omega} \times J\boldsymbol{\omega} + \boldsymbol{\tau}, \quad (4)$$

where $\mathbf{F}_b = [0, 0, f_b]^T$ is the force applied to the vehicle expressed in $\sum_b$, g is the gravity constant, $\boldsymbol{\tau}$ is the torque applied to the vehicle, $\boldsymbol{\Delta}_t = [\Delta_x, \Delta_y, \Delta_z]^T$ is the external disturbance in the translational dynamics and $\boldsymbol{\omega}$ is the angular velocity of the quadrotor. We further assume that the external disturbance are small time varying and bounded, that is $\|\boldsymbol{\Delta}_t\| \leq \delta_t$ where δ_t is known constant.

In most autopilot, a hierarchical control scheme as shown in Fig. 2 is used for the quadrotor control. In our case, we only consider the translation dynamics. For the orientation dynamics of (4), a high-gain controller is used to ensure that attitude $\boldsymbol{\phi}$ converges to the desired attitude $\boldsymbol{\phi}_d$. The translational dynamics of the quadrotor are shown in (2) (3) and also can be represented as

$$m\ddot{x} = f_x + \Delta_x, \quad (5)$$

$$m\ddot{y} = f_y + \Delta_y, \quad (6)$$

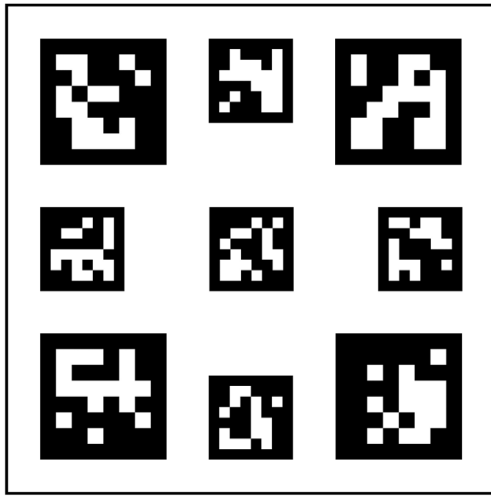


Fig. 3. Landing pad.

Table 1

Single marker vs. Multiple markers.

	Recall rate	Estimation precision
Single marker	99.1%	3.68 cm
Multiple markers	99.9%	3.12 cm

Table 2

Recall rate for different size markers at different distance.

	0.2 m	0.5 m	1 m	3 m	5 m	7 m
5 cm	100%	97.2%	88.4%	7.2%	0%	0%
10 cm	99.2%	99.1%	97.2%	89.3%	31.6%	18.7%
15 cm	96.2%	95.2%	99.1%	99.5%	90.2%	45.8%
20 cm	37.4%	90.2%	97.8%	99.7%	99.1%	84.1%
30 cm	0%	89.7%	95.1%	100%	100%	100%

Table 3

Estimation precision for different size markers at different distance.

	0.2 m	0.5 m	1 m	3 m	5 m	7 m
5 cm	2.73 cm	4.83 cm	9.84 cm	63.25 cm	–	–
10 cm	1.82 cm	3.29 cm	4.47 cm	12.61 cm	49.15 cm	80.36 cm
15 cm	1.64 cm	3.07 cm	3.68 cm	8.38 cm	15.26 cm	46.71 cm
20 cm	1.23 cm	2.38 cm	2.94 cm	6.77 cm	9.54 cm	18.63 cm
30 cm	–	1.72 cm	2.28 cm	4.49 cm	7.35 cm	10.83 cm

$$m\ddot{z} = f_z - mg + \Delta_z, \quad (7)$$

where $\mathbf{F}_w = [f_x, f_y, f_z]^T$ is the force applied to quadrotor expressed in world inertial frame. It can be written as

$$f_x = f_b (\sin \theta \cos \psi + \sin \varphi \cos \theta \sin \psi), \quad (8)$$

$$f_y = f_b (\sin \theta \sin \psi - \sin \varphi \cos \theta \cos \psi), \quad (9)$$

$$f_z = f_b \cos \varphi \cos \theta. \quad (10)$$

3. Detection method and landing pad design

In this section, the landing pad design and the onboard vision system for providing the relative pose between the quadrotor and the landing platform will be investigated.

3.1. Landing pad design & detection

To solve the negative influence caused by the low-cost camera, we design the landing pad as shown in Fig. 3. The landing pad consists of different size ArUco markers, which can make it can be detected by camera from high as well as low altitudes and decreases the possibility of loss of tracking target. The bigger patterns can be detected from high altitudes as shown in Fig. 4(a)(b). When the quadrotor is close to the platform during landing, these patterns gradually leave the camera Field of View (FOV), while the smaller ones could still be detected as shown in Fig. 4(c)(d). This configuration is designed to achieve the goals of keeping the desired target within the camera FOV and reducing measurement noise, which can compensate the influence of the low-cost monocular camera.

Comparing to single marker, multiple markers can increase the recall rate. The landing pad can be detected when at least one of the makers is detected. If the recall rate for each marker is p_i , the recall rate for multiple markers is $1 - \prod_i (1 - p_i)$. In addition, multiple markers can increase the detection accuracy. Because it can reduce the measurement noise to average the position of multiple markers. The estimation precision and recall rate are tested using single marker and our landing pad and the result is shown in Table 1.

Moreover, it is easy to modify detection range by changing the pattern size in terms of different application scenarios. In our case, the side length of the landing pad is 60 cm. The side length of big and small marker is 15 cm and 10 cm respectively. To choose a suitable landing pad, we need consider estimation precision and recall rate in different relative distance. Recall rate is defined as

$$\text{Recall} = \frac{TP}{TP + FP}. \quad (11)$$

where true positive (TP) is expressed as the total number of markers detected and decoded successfully, false positive (FP) as the total number of markers detected and decoded unsuccessfully.

To simulation the camera vibration in real application, we let the quadrotor hover in different altitudes and we test the recall rate and estimation precision for different size makers with 1500 images in each altitude. The result is shown in Tables 2 and 3.

From the table, we can find the estimation precision and recall rate is decided by the size of marker and the relative distance. In Table 1, generally, the recall rate is higher when the relative distance is smaller. However, when the relative distance is too small, some big marker cannot be detected. In Table 2, the estimation precision is better when the size of marker is bigger. However, the big marker will leave the camera FOV because of the maneuver of quadrotor. The choice of marker size has a trade-off between the recall rate and estimation precision.

The ArUco library [15] is chosen for the design of the landing pad and the onboard vision system. Its detection pipeline is more effective and faster than that of the similar AprilTag library [16], which is suited for our low-cost on-board computer. The marker detection process is composed of two main steps: the detection of marker candidates and codification analysis. In order to detect square shapes which are candidates, adaptive thresholding and contour extraction in combination with additional extra filtering are used in the detection process. The objective of the second step is to analyze inner codification. Firstly, perspective transformation is used to obtain the marker in canonical form. Then, aiming at the separation of white and black sections, Otsu thresholding method is used. Finally, bit by bit analysis is performed in order to determine whether the marker belongs to a specific marker dictionary.

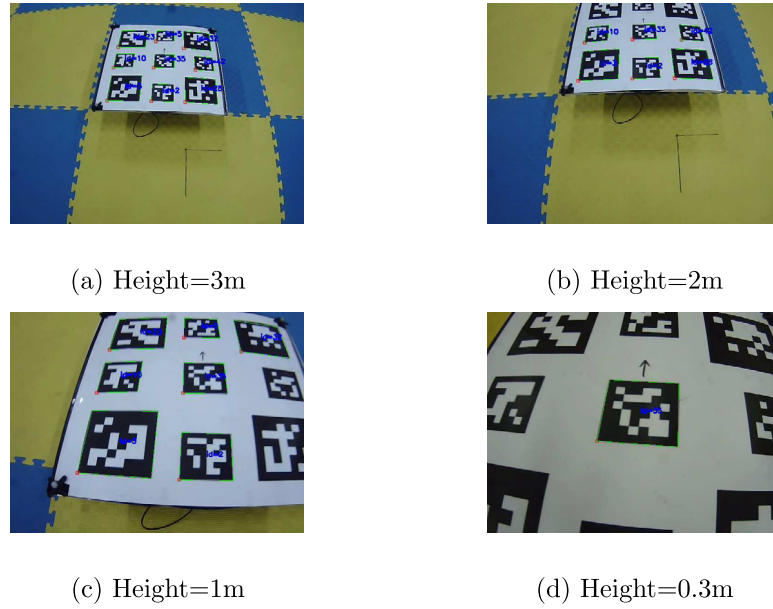


Fig. 4. Detection at different heights.

The detection algorithm provides the identity of all detected markers, with four corners of each marker in the image. Using the real size of the marker, it is sufficient to estimate its full relative pose of the landing pad in absolute scale.

3.2. Relative pose estimation

The problem of estimating the pose of a calibrated camera using n reference 3D points and their corresponding 2D projections is commonly referred as Perspective-n-Point (PnP) problem. Regarding the ArUco markers, non-iterative methods like Efficient Perspective-n-Point (EPnP) are not considered, because they are not robust in planar case. The homography method for planar targets [17] followed by non-linear optimization using the well-known Levenberg–Marquardt (LM) algorithm to minimize reprojection error is selected to estimate the transformation matrix T_{MC} from camera frame to marker frame. Then the relative attitude between quadrotor and landing pad can be calculated with T_{MC} and the quadrotor position in marker frame can be calculated as follows:

$$\begin{bmatrix} x_M \\ y_M \\ z_M \\ 1 \end{bmatrix} = T_{MC} \begin{bmatrix} x_C \\ y_C \\ z_C \\ 1 \end{bmatrix}, \quad (12)$$

where C denotes camera frame and M denotes marker frame.

It is more convenient to estimate the optic central position relative to the static markers than to estimate the marker position relative to the quadrotor. However, the planar surface of the landing pad and the limitation of the camera make mirror effect and occasional misidentification of some of the detected markers happen more frequently. So the method of just weighting the average of raw estimated pose could not provide accurate result.

Remark 1. In this paper, the cost function of PnP method is the sum of squared distances between the observed marker corners and the projected marker corners in image frame. The optimization problem is to find such a pose that minimizes reprojection error. However, the cost function of PnP has two distinct minima which would lead to significant unstable results when all marker corners lie on a plane. Compared to global shutter cameras, rolling

shutter cameras provide more noise which will influence the initial pose of the optimization problem. If the initial pose is closer to the local minima, a wrong relative pose will be solved. Because the wrong estimated pose and the true pose look like in two different sides of a mirror, we call it mirror effect.

To solve this issue, a 3D points cluster algorithm is implemented which does not need to define the amount of the clusters. Firstly, the error between two estimated positions $\mathbf{p}_i$ and $\mathbf{p}_j$ are defined in (13).

$$\text{error}_{ij} = \|\mathbf{p}_i - \mathbf{p}_j\|_2 \quad (13)$$

Then, a threshold is defined for checking whether two positions are in the same cluster. After checking all estimated positions, the cluster with the largest amount of data is the correct detection cluster. At last, weighted average of correct detection data is the optimal relative position and yaw angle between quadrotor and landing pad. Particularly, if more than one clusters contain the largest amount of data, then we choose the one which is the nearest to the last correct position as the correct detection cluster. The 3D points cluster algorithm is shown in Alg. 1.

Fig. 5 shows the relative position in x-axis using raw detection results and 3D point cluster algorithm respectively. In Fig. 5, it can be found that the position estimation result are inaccurate using raw detection results. By the contrary, the erroneous position estimations are completely removed after apply by the 3D point cluster algorithm. Fig. 6 shows the same improvement in the relative yaw estimation. The ground truth is measured by OptiTrack system.

To verify the robustness of the onboard vision system, let the quadrotor move from 0.5 m to 2.5 m in marker's x-axis at a constant altitude of 2 m. The mean error and standard deviation of the estimation result are shown in Table 4

4. Control law

The control component of the landing task includes a tracking problem and a backstepping position control law, which will be introduced in this section.

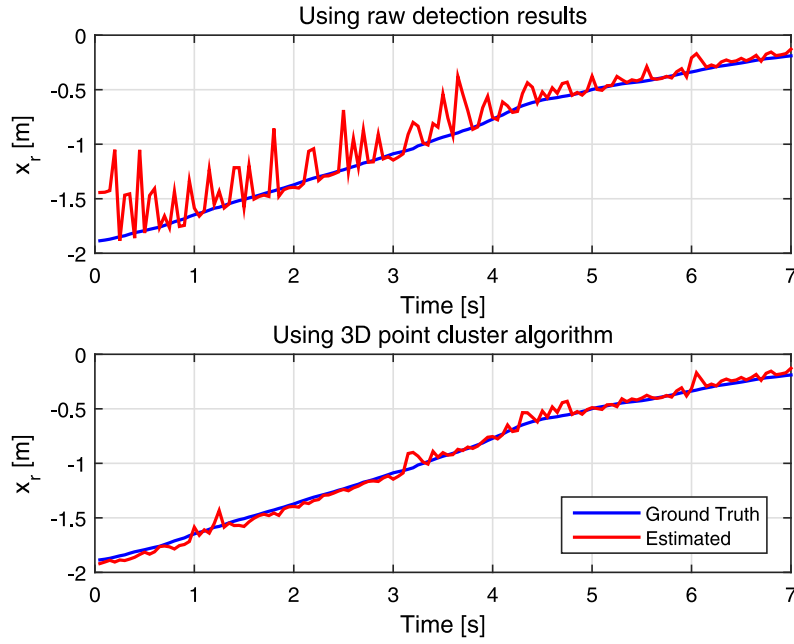


Fig. 5. Position estimation result.

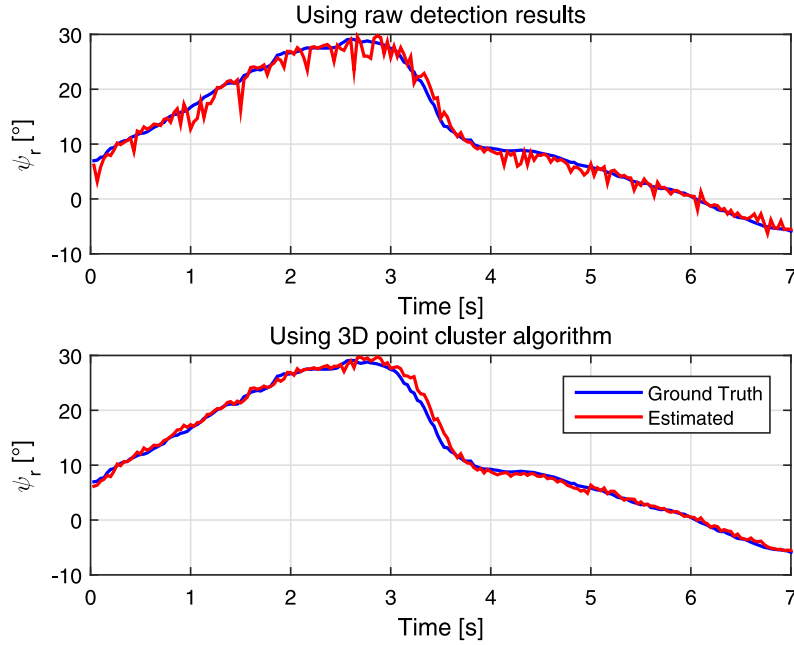


Fig. 6. Yaw estimation result.

Table 4
Estimation result at different distance.

Distance in x-axis (m)	0.5	1	1.5	2	2.5
Mean error (cm)	3.71	4.02	4.25	4.34	7.66
Standard deviation (cm)	4.13	4.53	4.84	5.37	9.12

4.1. Problem statement

As shown in Fig. 7, we assume that the landing pad is initially in the FOV of camera by ignoring the searching procedure.

From the onboard vision system, the position of the quadrotor in landing pad frame $\mathbf{p}_{uav}^l = [x_{uav}^l, y_{uav}^l, z_{uav}^l]^T$ and relative yaw angle $\Delta\psi$ can be measured. We exploit the knowledge of the

quadrotor's pose in the world inertial frame $\sum_w$ to calculate the position of the landing pad in $\sum_w$. Due to the camera is set in front of the quadrotor, we can get

$$x_l^w = x - x_{uav}^l \cos \Delta\psi + y_{uav}^l \sin \Delta\psi, \quad (14)$$

$$y_l^w = y - x_{uav}^l \sin \Delta\psi - y_{uav}^l \cos \Delta\psi, \quad (15)$$

$$z_l^w = z - z_{uav}^l, \quad (16)$$

where $[x_l^w, y_l^w, z_l^w]^T$ is the position of landing pad in world inertial frame $\sum_w$. Take the time derivative of (14), (15) and (16) and

Algorithm 1 3D points cluster algorithm

Input: D : a set of 3D points to be clustered; Yaw : a set of yaw angle corresponding to 3D points; p_{last} : last optimal points centroid; $threshold$: distance threshold;

Output: optimal points centroid c^* ; optimal yaw yaw^* ;

```

1:  $k=0$ (number of clusters);
2:  $N = \{n_1, n_2, \dots, n_k\}$ (set of clusters number);
3:  $C = \{c_1, c_2, \dots, c_k\}$ (set of cluster centroids);
4:  $Y = \{y_1, y_2, \dots, y_k\}$ (set of average yaw);
5: for all  $p_i \in D$  do
6:    $yaw_i \in Yaw$  corresponding to  $p_i$ ;
7:   if  $k = 0$  then
8:      $k \leftarrow 1$ ;  $n_1 \leftarrow 1$ ;
9:      $c_1 \leftarrow p_i$ ;  $y_1 \leftarrow yaw_i$ ;
10:  else
11:     $found \leftarrow false$ ;
12:    for  $j \leftarrow 1$  to  $k$  do
13:      if  $\|p_i - c_j\|_2 < threshold$  then
14:         $update(c_j, y_j)$ ;
15:         $n_j \leftarrow n_j + 1$ ;
16:         $found \leftarrow true$ ;
17:        break;
18:      end if
19:    end for
20:    if  $found = false$  then
21:       $k \leftarrow k + 1$ ;  $n_k \leftarrow 1$ ;
22:       $c_k \leftarrow p_i$ ;  $y_k \leftarrow yaw_i$ ;
23:    end if
24:  end if
25: end for
26:  $n_{max} = \max(N)$ ;
27: for all  $i$  such that  $(i \leq k)$  and  $(n_i = n_{max})$  do
28:    $index \leftarrow \arg \min_i \|c_i - p_{last}\|_2$ ;
29: end for
30:  $c^* \leftarrow c_{index}$ ;  $yaw^* \leftarrow y_{index}$ ;

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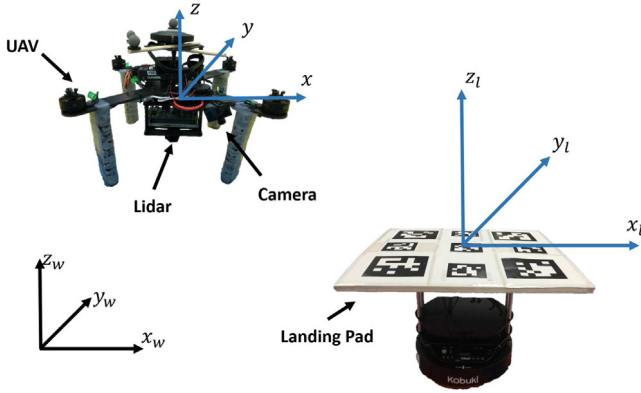


Fig. 7. Quadrotor and landing pad.

we can get

$$\dot{x}_l^w = \dot{x} - \dot{x}_{uav}^l \cos \Delta\psi + \dot{y}_{uav}^l \sin \Delta\psi + x_{uav}^l \Delta\dot{\psi} \sin \Delta\psi + y_{uav}^l \Delta\dot{\psi} \cos \Delta\psi, \quad (17)$$

$$\dot{y}_l^w = \dot{y} - \dot{x}_{uav}^l \sin \Delta\psi - \dot{y}_{uav}^l \cos \Delta\psi - x_{uav}^l \Delta\dot{\psi} \cos \Delta\psi + y_{uav}^l \Delta\dot{\psi} \sin \Delta\psi, \quad (18)$$

$$\dot{z}_l^w = \dot{z} - \dot{z}_{uav}^l. \quad (19)$$

The reference state of the position loop can be set as $\mathbf{p}_d = [\dot{x}_l^w, \dot{y}_l^w, \dot{z}_l^w]^T$ and $\mathbf{v}_d = [\dot{x}_l^w, \dot{y}_l^w, \dot{z}_l^w]^T$. A tracking control law is presented in next subsection ensuring that $\mathbf{p} \rightarrow \mathbf{p}_d$ and $\mathbf{v} \rightarrow \mathbf{v}_d$.

4.2. Control law

The main objective of this section is to design a backstepping position controller of quadrotor ensuring that the position $\mathbf{p}$ and velocity $\mathbf{v}$ tracks the desired position $\mathbf{p}_d$ and velocity $\mathbf{v}_d$ respectively. To enhance tracking of the position controller, an adaptive rule is described to account of the external disturbance.

Let the position error $\mathbf{z}_1 = \mathbf{p} - \mathbf{p}_d$ and $\dot{\mathbf{z}}_1 = \mathbf{v} - \mathbf{v}_d$. To apply the standard backstepping procedure, introduce the new state variable

$$\mathbf{z}_2 = \mathbf{v} - \boldsymbol{\alpha}, \quad (20)$$

where $\boldsymbol{\alpha}$ is a virtual control input. It would stabilize $\mathbf{z}_1$ to zero and is given by

$$\boldsymbol{\alpha} = -\mathbf{K}_1 \mathbf{z}_1 + \mathbf{v}_d, \quad (21)$$

where $\mathbf{K}_1 > 0$ is a positive diagonal matrix. From (20) and (21), the velocity tracking error can be written as

$$\dot{\mathbf{z}}_1 = -\mathbf{K}_1 \mathbf{z}_1 + \mathbf{z}_2. \quad (22)$$

Take the time derivative of (20) and using the equation of (5), (6) and (7) results in

$$\dot{\mathbf{z}}_2 = \dot{\mathbf{v}} - \dot{\mathbf{v}}_d + \mathbf{K}_1(\mathbf{v} - \mathbf{v}_d), \quad (23)$$

$$m\dot{\mathbf{z}}_2 = -mg\mathbf{e}_3 + \mathbf{F}_w + \Delta_t - m\dot{\mathbf{v}}_d + m\mathbf{K}_1(\mathbf{v} - \mathbf{v}_d). \quad (24)$$

Considering a Lyapunov function

$$\mathbf{V}(\mathbf{z}_1, \mathbf{z}_2, \tilde{\Delta}_t) = \frac{1}{2}\mathbf{z}_1^T \mathbf{z}_1 + \frac{1}{2}m\mathbf{z}_2^T \mathbf{z}_2 + \frac{1}{2}\tilde{\Delta}_t^T \Gamma^{-1} \tilde{\Delta}_t, \quad (25)$$

where $\Gamma > 0$ is a positive diagonal matrix, and $\tilde{\Delta}_t = \hat{\Delta}_t - \Delta_t$ is the external disturbance estimation error and $\hat{\Delta}_t$ is an estimate of the external disturbance Δ_t . The time derivative of $\mathbf{V}(\mathbf{z}_1, \mathbf{z}_2, \tilde{\Delta}_t)$ is

$$\begin{aligned} \dot{\mathbf{V}}(\mathbf{z}_1, \mathbf{z}_2, \tilde{\Delta}_t) &= \mathbf{z}_1^T \dot{\mathbf{z}}_1 + m\mathbf{z}_2^T \dot{\mathbf{z}}_2 + \tilde{\Delta}_t^T \Gamma^{-1} \dot{\tilde{\Delta}}_t \\ &= \mathbf{z}_1^T(\mathbf{v} - \mathbf{v}_d) + m\mathbf{z}_2^T \dot{\mathbf{z}}_2 + \tilde{\Delta}_t^T \Gamma^{-1} \dot{\tilde{\Delta}}_t \\ &= \mathbf{z}_1^T(\mathbf{z}_2 + \boldsymbol{\alpha} - \mathbf{v}_d) + m\mathbf{z}_2^T \dot{\mathbf{z}}_2 + \tilde{\Delta}_t^T \Gamma^{-1} \dot{\tilde{\Delta}}_t \\ &= \mathbf{z}_1^T \mathbf{z}_2 - \mathbf{z}_1^T \mathbf{K}_1 \mathbf{z}_1 + \tilde{\Delta}_t^T \Gamma^{-1} \dot{\tilde{\Delta}}_t \\ &\quad + \mathbf{z}_2^T(-mg\mathbf{e}_3 + \mathbf{F}_w + \Delta_t - m\dot{\mathbf{v}}_d + m\mathbf{K}_1(\mathbf{v} - \mathbf{v}_d)) \\ &= -\mathbf{z}_1^T \mathbf{K}_1 \mathbf{z}_1 + \tilde{\Delta}_t^T \Gamma^{-1} \dot{\tilde{\Delta}}_t \\ &\quad + \mathbf{z}_2^T(\mathbf{z}_1 - mg\mathbf{e}_3 + \mathbf{F}_w + \Delta_t - m\dot{\mathbf{v}}_d + m\mathbf{K}_1(\mathbf{v} - \mathbf{v}_d)). \end{aligned} \quad (26)$$

The stabilization of $\mathbf{z}_1$ and $\mathbf{z}_2$ can be obtained by constructing the control input and external disturbance estimate law as

$$\mathbf{F}_w = -\mathbf{z}_1 + mg\mathbf{e}_3 - \hat{\Delta}_t + m\dot{\mathbf{v}}_d - m\mathbf{K}_1(\mathbf{v} - \mathbf{v}_d) - \mathbf{K}_2 \mathbf{z}_2, \quad (27)$$

$$\dot{\hat{\Delta}}_t = \Gamma \mathbf{z}_2, \quad (28)$$

where $\mathbf{K}_2$ is a diagonal positive matrix. Substituting (27) and (28) to (26), we obtain

$$\dot{\mathbf{V}}(\mathbf{z}_1, \mathbf{z}_2, \tilde{\Delta}_t) = -\mathbf{z}_1^T \mathbf{K}_1 \mathbf{z}_1 - \mathbf{z}_2^T \mathbf{K}_2 \mathbf{z}_2 \leq 0. \quad (29)$$

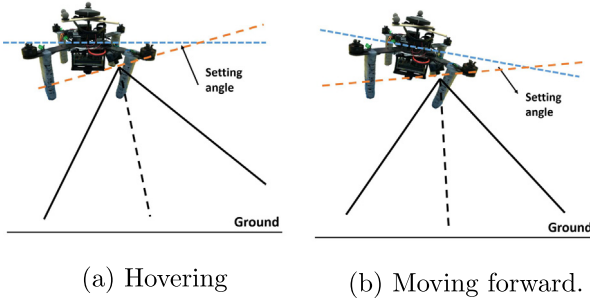


Fig. 8. Setting angle.

From (29), it is obvious to conclude that $\dot{V}(z_1, z_2, \tilde{\Delta}_t)$ is negative semi-definite. With (23), (27) and (28), closed-loop system (3) can be written as the following matrix form

$$\begin{bmatrix} \dot{z}_1 \\ \dot{z}_2 \end{bmatrix} = \begin{bmatrix} -K_1 & I \\ -\frac{1}{m}I & -\frac{1}{m}K_2 \end{bmatrix} \begin{bmatrix} z_1 \\ z_2 \end{bmatrix} + \begin{bmatrix} 0 \\ -\frac{1}{m}I \end{bmatrix} \tilde{\Delta}_t, \quad (30)$$

$$\dot{\tilde{\Delta}} = \begin{bmatrix} 0^T & \frac{1}{m}\Gamma \end{bmatrix} \begin{bmatrix} z_1 \\ mz_2 \end{bmatrix}. \quad (31)$$

In conclusion, the equilibrium of system (30) and (31) is uniformly asymptotically stable, which implies that $\mathbf{p} \rightarrow \mathbf{p}_d$ and $\mathbf{v} \rightarrow \mathbf{v}_d$.

With (8), (9) and (10), the reference state for the roll and pitch angles can be computed as

$$\phi_d = \arctan\left(\frac{f_x \cos \psi + f_y \sin \psi}{f_z}\right), \quad (32)$$

$$\theta_d = \arcsin\left(\frac{f_x \sin \psi - f_y \cos \psi}{f_b}\right). \quad (33)$$

The relative yaw angle $\Delta\psi$ between the quadrotor and landing pad can be obtained from the onboard vision system and the desired value of yaw angle can be computed as

$$\psi_d = \psi + \Delta\psi. \quad (34)$$

5. Landing strategies

In our quadrotor system, gimbal camera is not adopted because that it is expensive and will decrease the payload ability of the system. As we know that quadrotor changes its attitude to achieve translation movement. Towards a fixed camera, aggressive maneuvers may make the landing pad out of the camera FOV, which can in turn cause failure of the detection (especially in the case of a moving target). To avoid this situation, we setup the camera in front of the quadrotor with a setting angle. We assume that the landing pad is in front of the quadrotor. When the quadrotor moves forward, the landing pad is still in the camera FOV as shown in Fig. 8.

According to the aforementioned arguments, a landing scheme is proposed and the state machine diagram is given in Fig. 9.

At the beginning, the quadrotor searches for the landing platform. When more than two correct tags are detected by onboard vision system, the quadrotor starts to track the landing pad. Generally, the camera can detect more markers in a higher altitude. When the tracking of the pad is lost (no marker is detected), the quadrotor increases its altitude slowly, until the landing pad is redetected. We use the relative position error between the

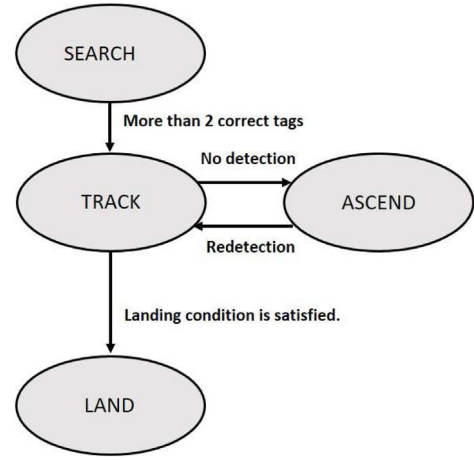


Fig. 9. State machine for landing.

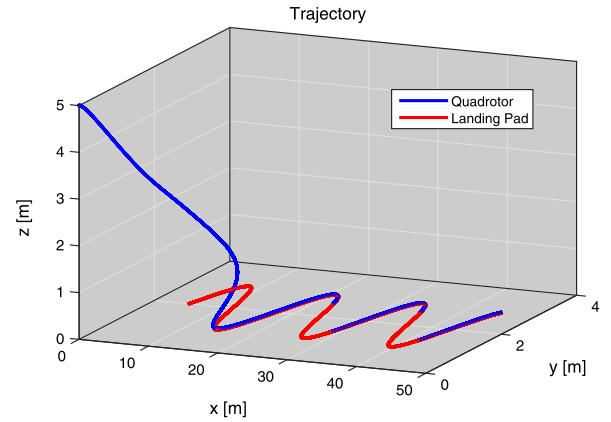


Fig. 10. Trajectory of quadrotor (blue line) and landing platform (red line). (For interpretation of the references to color in this figure legend, the reader is referred to the web version of this article.)

quadrotor and landing pad $\mathbf{p}_r = \mathbf{p} - \mathbf{p}_l$ as the landing criteria. The landing condition is satisfied when

$$\mathbf{p}_r = \begin{bmatrix} x_r \\ y_r \\ z_r \end{bmatrix} \leq \begin{bmatrix} \delta_x \\ \delta_y \\ \delta_z \end{bmatrix}, \quad (35)$$

where δ_x , δ_y and δ_z are positive constants. If the landing condition (35) is satisfied, the motors will be turned off directly and then quadrotor will land on the landing pad quickly.

Because the accuracy of depth estimated by onboard vision system is limited, a facing downward single-point lidar is used to measure the accuracy vertical distance z_r between the quadrotor and the landing pad. It helps to determine the time to turn off motors and avoid the collision. Due to the ground effect, the stabilization of the quadrotor becomes extremely difficult when approaching the landing pad. Hence, the quadrotor will fly above the minimum altitude of the quadrotor $z_{\min} < \delta_z$, which can reduce the impact of the ground effect.

6. Simulation results

In this section, simulation results are shown to evaluate the efficiency of the proposed landing controller (27)–(28) on top of a high-gain inner-loop attitude controller. The presented simulations consider landing problem of the quadrotor on a moving platform.

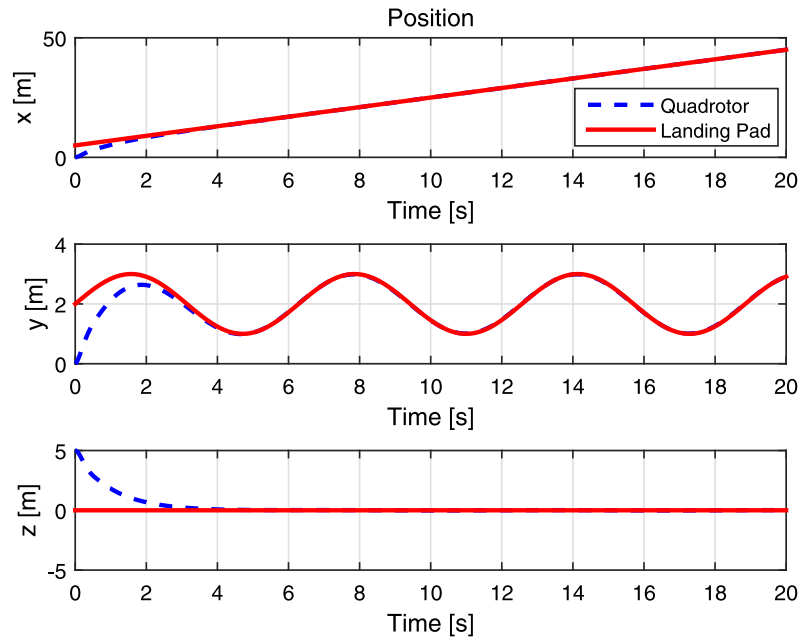


Fig. 11. Position of the quadrotor (dashed line) and position of the landing pad (solid line).

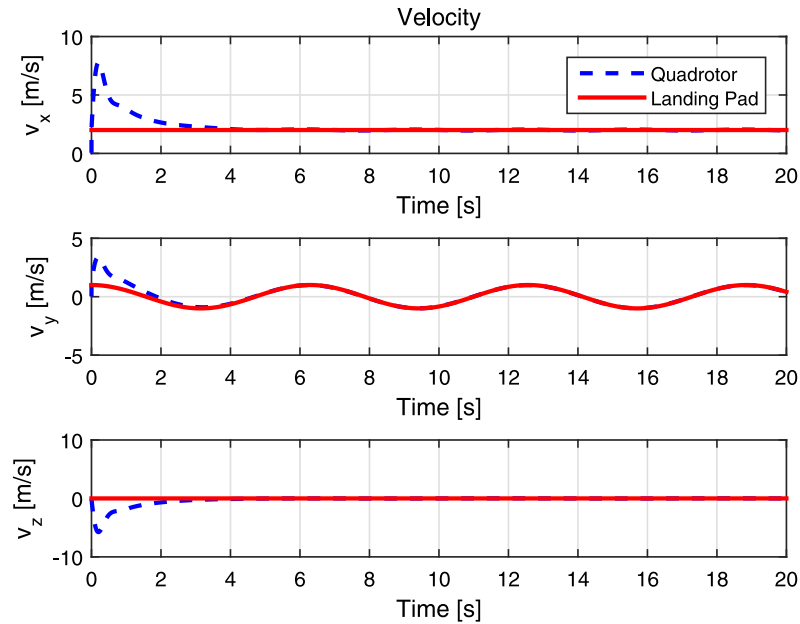


Fig. 12. Velocity of the quadrotor (dashed line) and velocity of the landing pad (solid line).

The mass of the vehicle is chosen $m = 1.1$ kg. It corresponds to the physical mass of the quadrotor that is used for experiments. At the beginning, the quadrotor hovers in the air and the initial position of the quadrotor is $\mathbf{p} = [0, 0, 5]$. The trajectory of landing platform is $\mathbf{p}_l = [5 + 2t, 2 + \sin(t), 0]$. The control gain is set to $K_1 = \text{diag}(1, 1, 1)$, $K_2 = \text{diag}(10, 10, 10)$ and $\Gamma = \text{diag}(90, 90, 90)$. The external disturbance are chosen as $\Delta_t = [2 + 2\sin(2t), 1 + 2\cos(t), -3 + 2\sin(t)]$. The simulation results are shown from Figs. 10 to 11. From these plots, it can be concluded that the numerical results illustrate the landing controller successful tracking performance.

Fig. 10 shows the trajectory of the quadrotor (blue line) and landing platform (red line) in 3-D space. Figs. 11 and 12 depict the position and the velocity of the quadrotor (dashed line) and

landing pad (solid line) with time. It can be seen that the position and velocity of the quadrotor can converge to the position and velocity of the landing pad. Fig. 13 depicts the external disturbance (solid line) and its estimation (dashed line). It can be seen that the estimation can converge to the external disturbance.

7. Experiment results

In this section, the proposed approach for autonomous landing is validated with two scenarios. This section presents the experimental setup and results of experiments including landing on a moving platform including linear movement and rotational movement. Then, analysis on the experimental results will be presented.

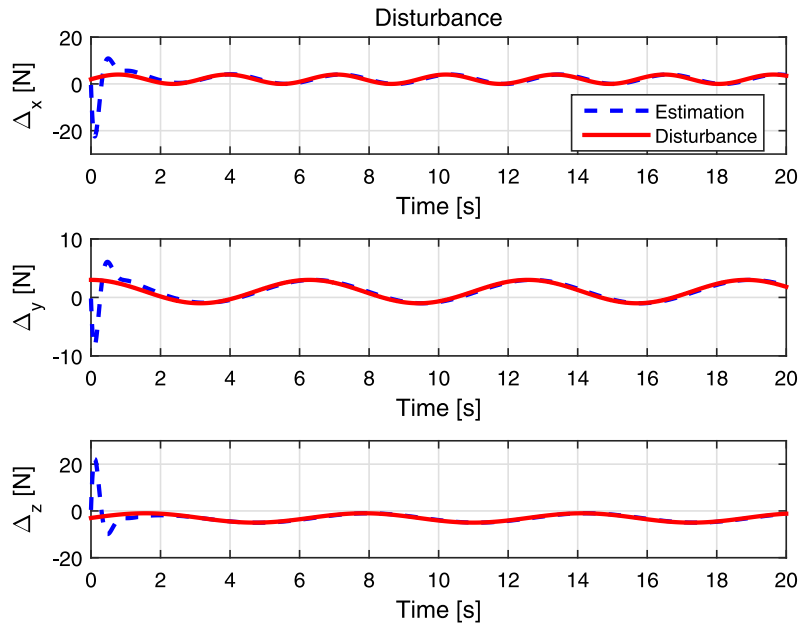


Fig. 13. External disturbance (solid line) and its estimation (dashed line).

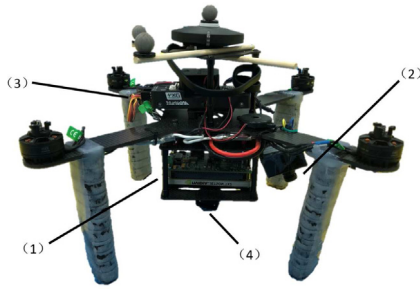


Fig. 14. Quadrotor and its components. (1) The onboard computer running our algorithms. (2) The monocular camera used for detection. (3) The PX4 autopilot. (4) The lidar used to measure altitude.

7.1. Experimental setup

The quadrotor used in this study is shown in Fig. 14. The overall system architecture, used to perform the experiments

for validation of autonomous landing, is shown in Fig. 15. The quadrotor is developed based on the off-the-shelf frame. It weighs about 1.1 kg with battery included and the arm length from the center of mass to each motor is 20 cm. An open source autopilot hardware (Pixhawk [18]) and autopilot software (PX4 [19]) was adopted. The onboard computer (Nvidia TX1 [20]) with a ARM processor running at 1.7 GHz runs three major software components:

- (1) interface with camera and lidar, detection algorithm and relative pose estimation;
- (2) computation of control inputs and state machine;
- (3) interface with flight controller, sending control inputs to the inner-loop controller [21].

In our experiment, the position of the quadrotor is measured by a motion capture system (OptiTrack [22]). Using the motion capture system can reduce the negative influence caused by inaccurate navigation system and we can focus on the negative influence caused by low-cost camera. Those values are computed at the ground computer and transmitted to the onboard computer via a Wi-Fi communication by vrpn-clinet-ros package [23]. The

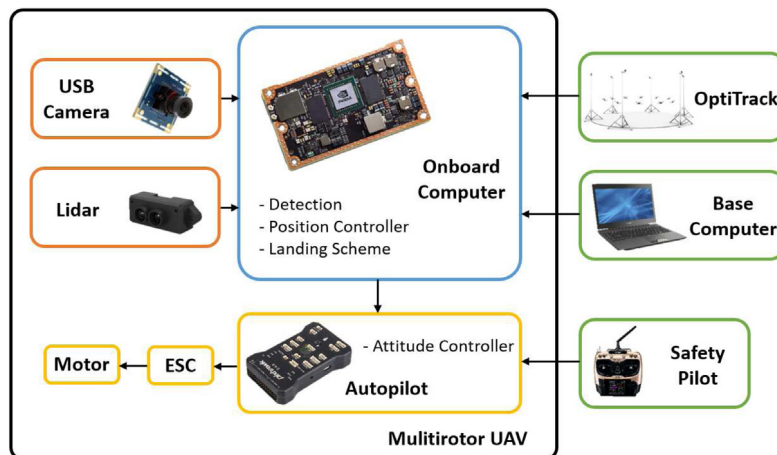


Fig. 15. Experiments setup.

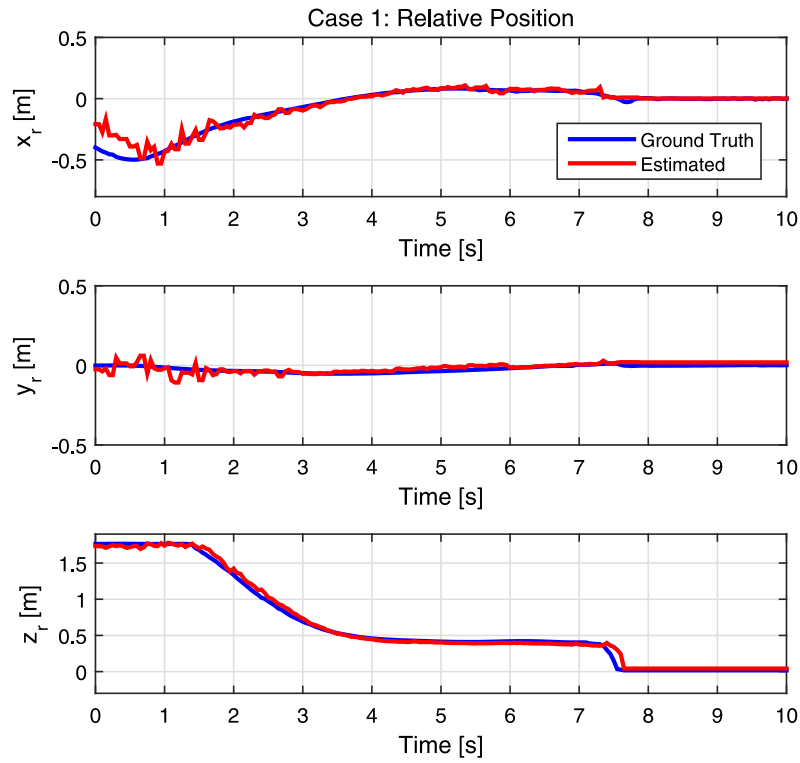


Fig. 16. Case 1: Relative position measured by Opti-Track (blue line) and onboard vision system (red line). (For interpretation of the references to color in this figure legend, the reader is referred to the web version of this article.)

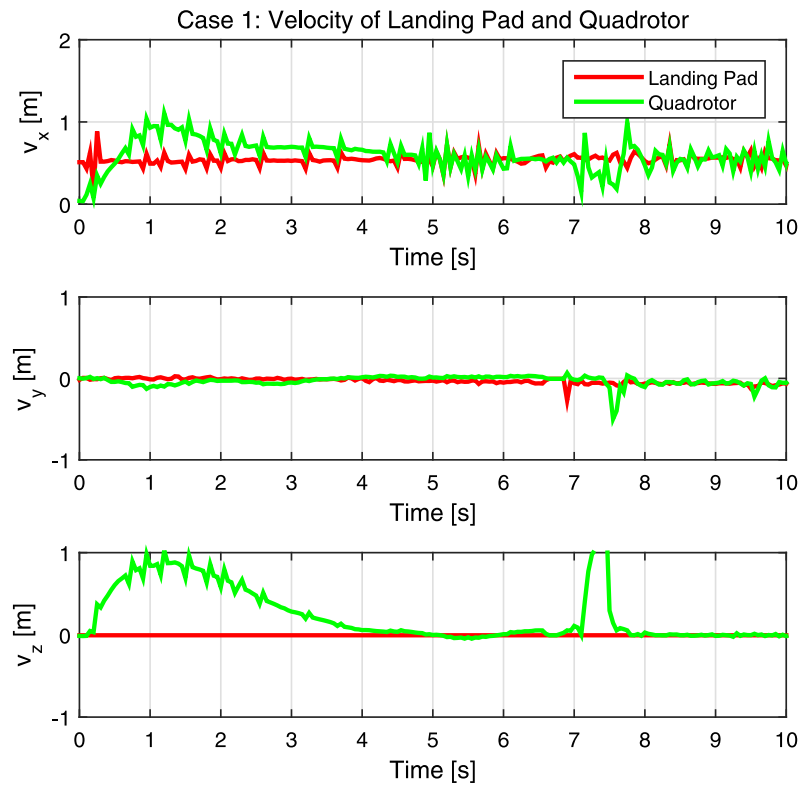


Fig. 17. Case 1: Velocities of quadrotor (green line) and landing pad (red line). (For interpretation of the references to color in this figure legend, the reader is referred to the web version of this article.)

landing pad is fixed on the Turtle Bot [24] which can achieve linear and rotational movement. To detect the landing pad, a

monocular camera is fixed in front of the quadrotor with a setting angle. The camera has about 90° FOV and the resolution of the

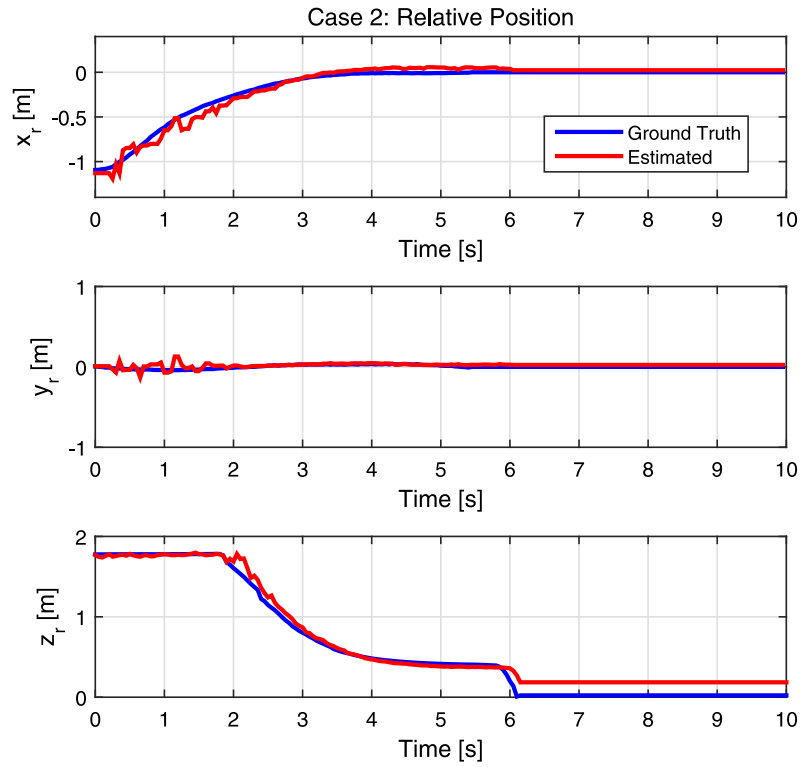


Fig. 18. Case 2: Relative position measured by Opti-Track (blue line) and onboard vision system (red line). (For interpretation of the references to color in this figure legend, the reader is referred to the web version of this article.)

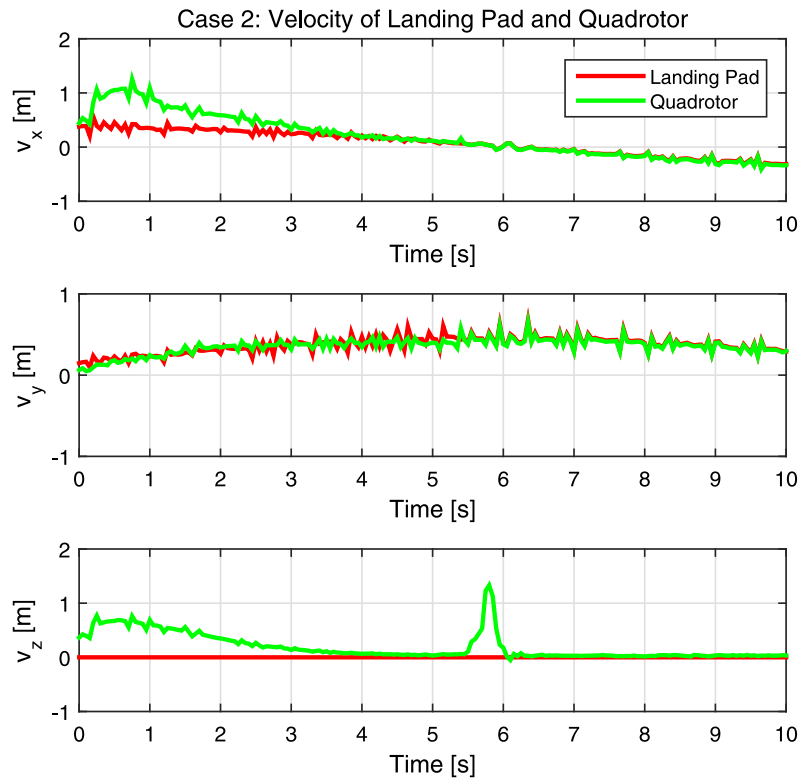


Fig. 19. Case 2: Velocities of quadrotor (green line) and landing pad (red line). (For interpretation of the references to color in this figure legend, the reader is referred to the web version of this article.)

Table 5

Total cost of the quadrotor.

Hardware	Price (USD)
Nvidia TX1	250
Pixhawk	60
Camera	20
Lidar	15
Frame	10
Other components	10
Total cost	365

image is 640*480 with 100 fps. The total cost of our quadrotor is shown in Table 5. The average price of global shutter camera without lens in [6,8,11] is 340 USD.

The high price of Nvidia TX1 is mainly on the GPU, which is not used in our system. In addition, its CPU computing power is far beyond the amount of calculation in our task. For our task (including image processing and control input calculation), the CPU utilization of Nvidia TX1 is only 20% as shown in bellowing figure. And It can be seen that our task can be achieved using other low-cost onboard computer, e.g. Raspberry Pi, Odroid XU4.

7.2. Experiment results: Case 1

In Case 1, this section presents the autonomous landing scenario on a linear moving landing pad. For brevity, the landing platform moves on a straight line alone x axes at 0.5 m/s. The experiment results are presented in Figs. 16 and 17. We choose the same control gains as simulation case. For the landing criteria, we choose $\delta_x = 5$ cm, $\delta_y = 5$ cm, $\delta_z = 40$ cm and $z_{\min} = 30$ cm. Fig. 16 depicts the relative position between the quadrotor and landing pad $\mathbf{p}_r = [x_r, y_r, z_r]^T$. The red line represents the estimated value from onboard vision system and blue line represents the ground truth from OptiTrack. It can be seen that the estimation results coincide with ground truth and the relative position x_r, y_r, z_r converges to zero. Fig. 17 shows the time history of the velocities of quadrotor (green line) and landing pad (red line). It can be seen that the quadrotor's horizontal velocity tracks the platform's steadily and the vertical velocity converges to zero. When the landing criteria is satisfied, the quadrotor will drop on the landing pad. Therefore, there is a sudden change at 7.2 s in z axes.

7.3. Experiment results: Case 2

In Case 2, this section presents the autonomous landing scenario on a circular moving landing pad. The landing moves with a linear velocity at 0.5 m/s and rotational velocity at 0.2 rad/s. We choose the same control gains and landing criteria as Case 1. The experimental results are shown from Figs. 18 to 20. Fig. 18 depicts the relative position between the quadrotor and landing pad measured by OptiTrack (blue line) and onboard vision system (red line) respectively. Note that estimated value of z_r at the end of the mission is not zero, because the landing platform is out of the FOV of vision system when they are close enough. Fig. 19 shows the time history of the velocities of quadrotor (green line) and landing pad (red line). Fig. 20 shows the evolution of the yaw angle of the quadrotor (green line) and landing pad (red line). It can be seen that the yaw angle of the quadrotor tracks the yaw angle of the landing pad steadily.

8. Conclusion

In this paper, we present a low-cost vision-based quadrotor system capable of autonomous landing on a moving platform. For the autonomous landing task, the dynamic model of the

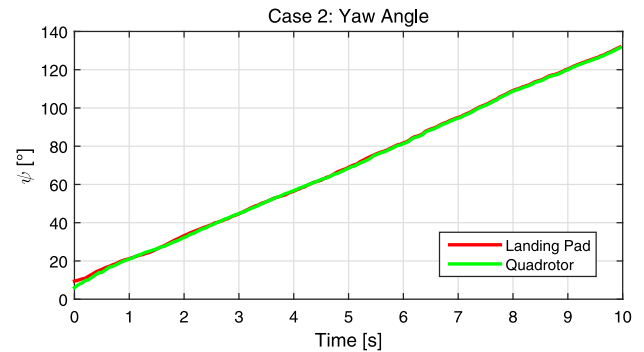


Fig. 20. Case 2: Yaw angle of quadrotor (green line) and landing pad (red line). (For interpretation of the references to color in this figure legend, the reader is referred to the web version of this article.)

quadrotor is simplified. A novel landing pad is designed for robust detection, ensuring detectability from high as well as low altitude. A 3D point cluster algorithm for pose estimation is presented to solve the problem of mirror effect and occasional misidentification. Based on the backstepping approach, an adaptive position controller was designed to enhance the landing task robustness and stability. Some landing strategies are presented to decrease the negative influence caused by low-cost system. In future work, we plan to improve the estimation accuracy of vision system and test our control law in outdoor environment.

Supplementary data

The video of the experiments can be found in https://v.youku.com/v_show/id_XMzc3ODM3MTQ4OA==.html?firsttime=2 or <https://youtu.be/EaPGlvZqMnE>

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Declaration of competing interest

No author associated with this paper has disclosed any potential or pertinent conflicts which may be perceived to have impending conflict with this work. For full disclosure statements refer to <https://doi.org/10.1016/j.robot.2019.05.004>.

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